Federated SHAP: Privacy-Preserving, Per-Node Explainability and Sensitivity Analysis for Pediatric Sepsis Prediction

Anonymous Author(s)

Abstract

Federated learning enables multi-hospital pediatric sepsis prediction without centralizing patient records, but a federated model remains a black box to the clinicians who must act on it: federation solves privacy, not trust. We present a federated SHAP explainability pipeline that computes Shapley attributions *locally* at each of five simulated ICU-type nodes on a shared global model, aggregates them using the same sample-size weighting FedAvg itself uses for model updates, and never transmits raw patient data or per-patient attributions off a node. On a Feature Tokenizer Transformer trained via FedAvg and FedProx across non-IID ICU nodes derived from the Pediatric Intensive Care (PIC) database with Phoenix Sepsis Criteria labelling, we find that `lactate_max` is the unanimous top feature at all five nodes, and every node's local SHAP ranking correlates strongly with the federated aggregate (Spearman ρ between 0.930 and 0.974 across all five nodes, including the smallest node, CICU, 5.7% of training data, and the largest, General ICU, 49.4%). FedAvg and FedProx further agree on 4 of their top 5 federated features ($\rho = 0.689$, $p = 5.4 \times 10^{-33}$). These results indicate that per-node federated explainability is both computationally practical and robust to severe non-IID node-size imbalance, at least along the algorithm-choice axis evaluated here.

CCS Concepts

• **Computing methodologies** → **Distributed computing methodologies**; **Machine learning**; • **Applied computing** → **Health informatics**; • **Security and privacy** → *Human and societal aspects of security and privacy*.

Keywords

Federated learning, explainable AI, SHAP, pediatric sepsis, Phoenix criteria, privacy-preserving machine learning

ACM Reference Format:

Anonymous Author(s). 2027. Federated SHAP: Privacy-Preserving, Per-Node Explainability and Sensitivity Analysis for Pediatric Sepsis Prediction. In *Proceedings of the ACM Conference on Trustworthy and Responsible AI and Computing Systems (TRUST '27), March 7–9, 2027, Washington, DC, USA.* ACM, New York, NY, USA, 5 pages.

1 Introduction

Pediatric sepsis progresses from suspected infection to multi-organ failure within hours, and delays in recognition of even one hour are associated with measurably higher mortality. An estimated 25 million pediatric sepsis cases occur annually worldwide, with mortality ranging from approximately 4% in mild presentations to over 50% in septic shock. To diagnose this condition, the Phoenix Sepsis Criteria established by Sanchez-Pinto et al. [11] and Schlapbach et al. [12] superseded prior SIRS-based definitions by Goldstein et al. [5] by establishing explicit diagnostic thresholds across cardiovascular, coagulation, respiratory, and neurological systems, serving as the ground-truth labelling framework in this study.

Federated learning (FL) offers a compelling paradigm for collaborative training of sepsis risk estimators across distributed medical centers without moving confidential electronic health records off-site—a prerequisite enforced by stringent clinical data privacy mandates. The Federated Averaging (FedAvg) algorithm proposed by McMahan et al. [10] and the FedProx framework developed by Li et al. [8] serve as the primary decentralized optimization methods analyzed in this investigation. Nevertheless, privacy-preserving training guarantees confidentiality only during model synthesis; it fails to provide clinical transparency for the learned decision boundaries. A clinician at a small-volume Cardiac ICU node has no way to verify that a model trained mostly on a much larger General ICU node's patients is reasoning correctly about their own, potentially very different, patient population.

This is the specific gap this paper addresses. The SHAP framework introduced by Lundberg and Lee [9] is the standard framework for post-hoc model explanation in clinical machine learning, and is increasingly treated as a precondition for deploying high-risk medical AI, as surveyed by Athukorala and Ilmini [1]. But SHAP explainability work in the sepsis literature has, to date, only ever been applied to centralized models trained on pooled data, such as recent work by Chanci et al. [2]. No published study combines federated training with *federated* explainability – i.e., SHAP computed locally at each participating site and aggregated without any node's raw data or per-patient attributions ever leaving that site.

Contributions. This paper makes four main contributions:

(1) A federated SHAP pipeline that computes GradientSHAP locally at each node and aggregates it with the same sample-size weighting FedAvg uses for model updates;
(2) An empirical evaluation showing that per-node explanations agree strongly with the federated aggregate despite severe non-IID node-size imbalance (one node holds 49.4% of all training data, another only 5.7%);
(3) A sensitivity analysis confirming this agreement is not an artifact of the choice of federated optimization algorithm; and
(4) A fully specified privacy boundary detailing precisely what is and is not transmitted off a node at explanation time, not just at training time.

Permission to make digital or hard copies of all or part of this work for personal or classroom use is granted without fee provided that copies are not made or distributed for profit or commercial advantage and that copies bear this notice and the full citation on the first page. Copyrights for components of this work owned by others than the author(s) must be honored. Abstracting with credit is permitted. To copy otherwise, or republish, to post on servers or to redistribute to lists, requires prior specific permission and/or a fee. Request permissions from permissions@acm.org.

TRUST 2027, Washington, DC, USA

© 2027 Copyright held by the owner/author(s). Publication rights licensed to ACM.

2 Related Work

2.1 Pediatric Sepsis Prediction

Machine learning applications in critical care sepsis diagnosis have expanded rapidly, with broad literature surveys indexing upward of 150 unique predictive models, such as comprehensive meta-analyses by Fleuren et al. [4] and Yang et al. [13]. The vast majority of published benchmarks concentrate on adult critical care repositories like MIMIC-III and MIMIC-IV, whereas investigations dedicated to pediatric demographics remain infrequent. Le et al. [7] developed an early pediatric-focused severe sepsis predictor using institutional PICU records from UCSF, but operated without decentralized or privacy-preserving mechanics. Deng et al. [3] identified that subtle target leakage and fragile validation schemes remain pervasive shortcomings across critical care predictive modeling, issues our pipeline mitigates through explicit pre-split leakage audits. Chanci et al. [2] recently introduced daily Phoenix-based pediatric sepsis models achieving competitive discrimination, but restricted their scope to isolated single-center datasets without interpretive post-hoc explainability mechanisms—the exact methodological divide this paper bridges.

2.2 Federated Learning in Healthcare

Under standard FedAvg proposed by McMahan et al. [10], client weight parameters are synthesized at the central server via a client-volume proportional weighted sum. FedProx, developed by Li et al. [8], introduces an additional proximal regularization penalty to each local objective function to stabilize distributed convergence when encountering severe statistical heterogeneity across participating client silos. Both optimization schemes are implemented and evaluated here to assess whether the resulting model interpretability landscapes remain consistent across optimization paradigms.

2.3 Explainable AI in Critical Care

Lundberg and Lee [9] established the SHAP framework by connecting additive feature importance to classic cooperative game theory, proving that Shapley values uniquely guarantee essential axiomatic properties including efficiency, null player, symmetry, and additivity. When explaining deep neural architectures on tabular clinical data—such as the Feature Tokenizer Transformer (FT-Transformer) introduced by Gorishniy et al. [6] and adopted here—gradient-guided sampling schemes like GradientSHAP are required, because TreeSHAP cannot operate on neural backbones. Transparent reasoning is increasingly demanded by regulatory bodies prior to the clinical integration of automated triage assistants, as underscored by Athukorala and Ilmini [1]. However, decentralized evaluation of feature attributions across federated healthcare nodes without sharing patient-level attributions has not been systematically investigated.

2.4 The PIC Database

The Pediatric Intensive Care (PIC) database introduced by Zeng et al. [14] is a bilingual, freely accessible pediatric electronic health record repository compiled at the Children's Hospital affiliated with Zhejiang University School of Medicine. It is distributed through PhysioNet to verified investigators and forms the empirical foundation of this work.

3 Methodology

3.1 Dataset and Federated Learning Setup

The dataset comprises a leakage-audited, Phoenix-labelled cohort derived from PIC v1.1.0, restricted to patients with clinically suspected infection. The clean feature matrix contains 225 features per patient. Training data (n = 2,530) is partitioned into five simulated ICU-type nodes by care-unit designation: CICU (Cardiac ICU, n = 144), NICU (Neonatal ICU, n = 421), PICU (Paediatric ICU, n = 213), SICU (Surgical ICU, n = 501), and General ICU (n = 1,251). This partition is deliberately non-IID: the General ICU node alone holds 49.4% of all training data, 8.7× the size of the smallest node (CICU) and 5.9× the PICU node. During the entire training lifecycle, patient records never migrate outside their originating node; the server orchestrates model convergence purely by dispatching and receiving parameter tensors.

The shared model architecture is an FT-Transformer [6] (2 transformer blocks, 256-dimensional embeddings, 8 attention heads), trained under two federated optimization strategies – FedAvg [10] and FedProx [8] – for 50 communication rounds with 5 local epochs per round, using inverse-prevalence class weighting to address the sepsis class imbalance. Feature values are standardized using a single StandardScaler fit on the pooled training distribution prior to federated partitioning, consistent with a realistic deployment where feature scaling statistics are agreed upon centrally before training begins, and applied identically at every node thereafter, including at explanation time.

3.2 Federated SHAP Explainability Pipeline

Given the final global model (from either FedAvg or FedProx), SHAP attributions are computed in five distinct steps:

(1) **Distribute weights.** The final global FT-Transformer is sent to each of the five nodes.
(2) **Local SHAP, on-site.** At each node, GradientSHAP is computed independently on that node's own held-out test patients. TreeSHAP is not applicable here, as the shared model is a differentiable neural network, not a tree ensemble.
(3) **Share summaries only.** Each node computes and transmits only its mean absolute SHAP value per feature – a single 225-dimensional vector – never raw patient data or per-patient attribution vectors.
(4) **Weighted aggregation.** A federated feature ranking is formed as:

$$\text{federated_SHAP}_j = \sum_{k=1}^{5} \frac{n_k}{N} \cdot \overline{|\text{SHAP}|}_{k,j} \tag{1}$$

where n_k is node k's sample size, $N = \sum_k n_k$, and $\overline{|\text{SHAP}|}_{k,j}$ is node k's mean absolute SHAP value for feature j – the same sample-size weighting FedAvg itself uses for model updates, applied here to explanations instead.
(5) **Comparative evaluation.** Each node's own local ranking is compared against the federated aggregate via Spearman

Table 1: Data flow and boundary guarantees at explanation time

Stays at the Local Node	Sent to Central Aggregator
Raw patient records & EHR traces	One mean |SHAP| vector per node (1×225)
Individual per-patient SHAP vectors	Local node sample size n_k
Local background reference sample	(already public: care-unit designation & count)

Table 2: Federated model classification performance on the test cohort

Configuration	AUROC	AUPRC	Sensitivity	Specificity
FedAvg (50 rounds)	0.9451	0.8897	0.8960	0.8609
FedProx ($\mu = 0.01$)	0.9557	0.9096	0.9017	0.8435

rank correlation, testing whether the combined explanation is representative of every node or is dominated by the largest one.

3.3 Sensitivity Analysis Design

Robustness of both model performance and its explanations was assessed along three axes. The algorithm axis – comparing FedAvg-trained and FedProx-trained global models' federated feature rankings via Spearman correlation and top-5 overlap – was completed and is reported in Section 4. Two further axes, cohort definition (the full intermediate ICU cohort versus the infection-restricted cohort used throughout this work) and alternate non-IID partitioning (e.g., by age band rather than care-unit type), were designed but not executed in time for this submission; see Section 5.

3.4 Privacy Boundary Analysis

Table 1 specifies precisely what data crosses a node boundary at explanation time, mirroring the guarantee FedAvg already provides at training time.

3.5 Computational Environment

All model architectures and federated pipelines were implemented using Python 3.10 and PyTorch 2.1 on an Apple Silicon computational environment. GradientSHAP attributions were computed using the Captum (v0.7.0) interpretability library. Feature preprocessing, cross-validation partitions, and discriminative performance metrics (AUROC, AUPRC, sensitivity, and specificity) were generated using Scikit-learn (v1.3.0), and rank correlation statistics (Spearman ρ and two-tailed asymptotic p-values) were computed with SciPy (v1.11.0).

4 Results

4.1 Federated Learning Performance

The overall classification performance across both federated regimes is summarized in Table 2. Both models attain high discriminative capacity, with FedProx demonstrating slight gains across AUROC (0.9557 vs. 0.9451) and AUPRC (0.9096 vs. 0.8897).

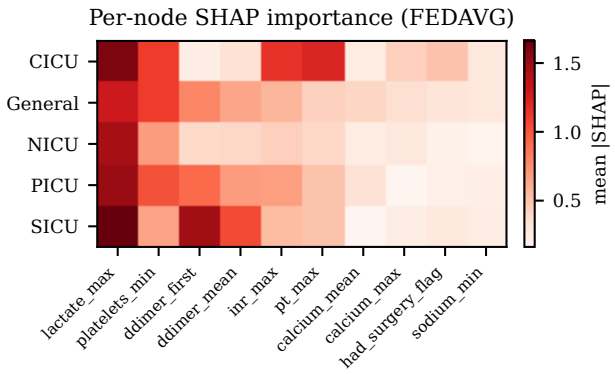


Figure 1: Per-node mean |SHAP| across the top federated clinical features.

Table 3: Spearman rank correlation, node ranking vs. federated aggregate (FedAvg)

Node	Spearman ρ	p-value
CICU	0.9297	1.10×10^{-98}
NICU	0.9498	1.77×10^{-114}
PICU	0.9739	1.47×10^{-145}
SICU	0.9661	4.16×10^{-133}
General	0.9704	1.48×10^{-139}

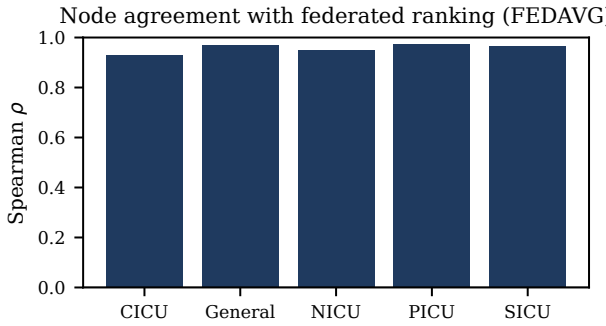


Figure 2: Spearman rank correlation of each node's local SHAP ranking against the federated aggregate.

4.2 Node-Level SHAP Rankings

Figure 1 shows, for each of the five nodes, mean absolute SHAP value across the top federated features. `lactate_max` is the unanimous top-ranked feature at every one of the five nodes, the only feature with this property; `platelets_min` and `ddimer_first` are consistently ranked second and third across most nodes as well.

4.3 Node vs. Federated Agreement

Table 3 and Figure 2 present the concordance between each local node's feature attributions and the aggregated federated ranking.

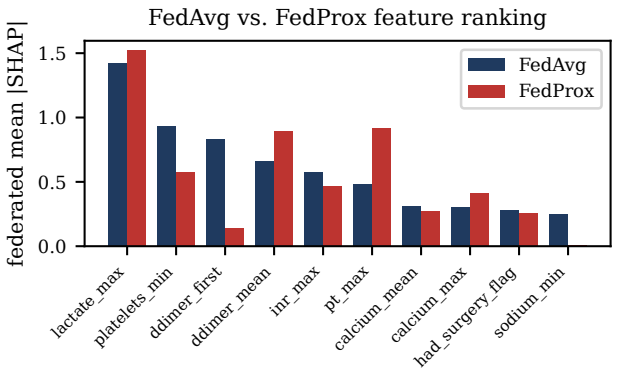


Figure 3: Comparison of federated SHAP rankings under FedAvg versus FedProx.

Every node correlates strongly with the federated aggregate, with Spearman ρ ranging narrowly from 0.930 to 0.974. Notably, General ICU – the dominant node at 49.4% of all training data – does *not* show the highest agreement ($\rho = 0.970$, the second-highest of the five); that distinction belongs to PICU ($\rho = 0.974$). The *lowest* agreement instead belongs to CICU, the smallest node at only 5.7% of training data ($\rho = 0.930$), though even this minimum remains high in absolute terms. This is the opposite of the pattern that would indicate the federated aggregate is simply reproducing the dominant node's reasoning: if that were the case, General ICU's agreement would be near-perfect while the smaller nodes trailed well behind. Instead, all five nodes – including both the largest and the smallest – cluster within a 0.044 range of each other, suggesting the federated model has learned a reasoning pattern that generalizes across care-unit types rather than one dominated by whichever node contributed the most training data.

4.4 Sensitivity Analysis: FedAvg vs. FedProx

Figure 3 compares the federated feature ranking produced under each optimization algorithm. The two algorithms agree on 4 of their top 5 federated features – `lactate_max`, `platelets_min`, `ddimer_mean`, and `inr_max` – with an overall Spearman rank correlation across all 225 features of $\rho = 0.689$ ($p = 5.36 \times 10^{-33}$). While lower than the per-node agreement reported above, this still represents a strong positive correlation and confirms that the feature-importance pattern driving Section 4's findings is not an artifact of which federated optimizer was used to train the underlying model.

5 Discussion

The central empirical question this paper set out to answer was whether a federated model's explanation is trustworthy at every participating site, or only at the site that happened to contribute the most training data. The results in Section 4 answer this directly: node-level agreement with the federated aggregate is uniformly high (Spearman ρ between 0.930 and 0.974) and does not track node size. If the federated SHAP aggregate were simply amplifying General ICU's reasoning, General ICU's own ranking should align with it almost perfectly while CICU, NICU, SICU, and PICU trailed visibly behind; instead, General ICU sits in the middle of the pack, and the smallest node, CICU, shows only a modestly lower – still high – correlation. This is a reassuring result for multi-site federated deployment: it suggests that aggregating SHAP values with the same sample-size weighting used for model updates does not inherit a bias toward the largest contributor's local feature distribution, at least under the care-unit-based non-IID partition evaluated here.

`lactate_max` being the unanimous top feature across all five nodes reinforces this reading. Lactate is a direct marker of tissue hypoperfusion and a clinically well-established early indicator of septic shock; its consistent dominance across structurally different care units (a Cardiac ICU population and a Neonatal ICU population, for instance, have very different baseline physiology) is consistent with a model that has learned a genuine, generalizable physiological signal rather than a node-specific correlation. The FedAvg/FedProx agreement in Section 4 (4 of 5 top features shared, $\rho = 0.689$) provides a second, independent line of evidence for the same conclusion: even changing the federated optimization algorithm entirely leaves the core explanation largely intact.

These findings should be read as applying to the single sensitivity axis completed in this work – the choice of federated algorithm – and not yet to variation in cohort definition or node partitioning strategy, both of which remain open questions discussed below.

5.1 Limitations and Future Work

The federated learning simulation partitions a single database by care-unit designation rather than drawing on genuinely separate institutional data sources; results here establish a lower bound on the practical cost of federation and of federated explainability, not a guarantee that a real multi-hospital deployment would behave identically. Of the three sensitivity axes designed for this work, only the algorithm-choice axis (FedAvg versus FedProx) was completed in time for this submission. The cohort-definition axis (re-running the full pipeline on the complete intermediate ICU cohort rather than the infection-restricted cohort used throughout) and the alternate-partition axis (grouping nodes by a criterion other than care-unit type, such as age band) were designed but not executed, and remain the most direct next steps for strengthening the robustness claims made in Section 5.

6 Conclusion

We introduced an interpretable federated SHAP architecture tailored for pediatric sepsis risk prediction, computing Shapley attributions locally at each of five simulated, non-IID ICU-type nodes and aggregating them with the same sample-size weighting used for federated model updates, without any node's raw patient data or per-patient attributions ever leaving that node. Across all five nodes, local SHAP rankings correlated strongly with the federated aggregate (Spearman ρ between 0.930 and 0.974), with no evidence that the dominant node (49.4% of training data) disproportionately shaped the aggregate explanation relative to the smallest node (5.7%). `lactate_max` emerged as the unanimous top feature at every node, and this finding was further confirmed as robust to the choice of federated optimization algorithm, with FedAvg and FedProx agreeing on 4 of their top 5 federated features. Together, these

results suggest that per-node federated explainability is both practical to compute and trustworthy across heterogeneous clinical sites, at least along the one sensitivity axis evaluated to date. Extending this evaluation to cohort definition and alternate node partitioning, and validating the approach on genuinely separate institutional data rather than a simulated partition of a single database, are the natural next steps toward a deployable system.

GenAI Usage Disclosure

In accordance with ACM Publication Policies and TRUST 2027 Conference Guidelines, the authors disclose that generative AI tools were used solely for editing, grammar checking, and LaTeX typesetting assistance during manuscript preparation. No generative AI system was used for the conception of research hypotheses, data collection, experimental execution, or empirical analysis. The authors take full responsibility for all content, empirical results, and scientific conclusions presented in this work.

References

[1] V. S. Athukorala and W. M. K. S. Ilmini. 2026. Explainable AI for Critical Care: A Systematic Review of Interpretable Models for Sepsis and ICU Mortality Prediction. *BMC Medical Informatics and Decision Making* 26 (2026), 64. doi:10.1186/s12911-026-03344-0

[2] D. Chanci et al. 2025. Machine Learning Model for Daily Prediction of Pediatric Sepsis Using Phoenix Criteria. *Pediatric Research* 99, 2 (2025), 631–637. doi:10.1038/s41390-025-04221-8

[3] H.-F. Deng et al. 2022. Evaluating Machine Learning Models for Sepsis Prediction: A Systematic Review of Methodologies. *iScience* 25, 2 (2022), 103651. doi:10.1016/j.isci.2021.103651

[4] L. M. Fleuren, T. L. T. Klausch, C. L. Zwager, L. J. Schoonmade, T. Guo, L. F. Roggeveen, et al. 2020. Machine Learning for the Prediction of Sepsis: A Systematic Review and Meta-Analysis of Diagnostic Test Accuracy. *Intensive Care Medicine* 46, 3 (2020), 383–400. doi:10.1007/s00134-019-05872-y

[5] B. Goldstein, B. Giroir, and A. Randolph. 2005. International Pediatric Sepsis Consensus Conference: Definitions for Sepsis and Organ Dysfunction in Pediatrics. *Pediatric Critical Care Medicine* 6, 1 (2005), 2–8. doi:10.1097/01.PCC.0000149131.72248.E6

[6] Y. Gorishniy, I. Rubachev, V. Khrulkov, and A. Babenko. 2021. Revisiting Deep Learning Models for Tabular Data. In *Advances in Neural Information Processing Systems*, Vol. 34. 18932–18943. https://proceedings.neurips.cc/paper/2021/hash/9d444086d3c09b691079d4692797e87b-Abstract.html

[7] S. Le, J. Hoffman, C. Barton, J. C. Fitzgerald, A. Allen, E. Pellegrini, J. Calvert, and R. Das. 2019. Pediatric Severe Sepsis Prediction Using Machine Learning. *Frontiers in Pediatrics* 7 (2019), 413. doi:10.3389/fped.2019.00413

[8] T. Li, A. K. Sahu, M. Zaheer, M. Sanjabi, A. Talwalkar, and V. Smith. 2020. Federated Optimization in Heterogeneous Networks. *Proceedings of Machine Learning and Systems* 2 (2020), 429–450. https://proceedings.mlsys.org/paper/2020/hash/3a0295e0e1b3d395372551405026b47c-Abstract.html

[9] S. M. Lundberg and S.-I. Lee. 2017. A Unified Approach to Interpreting Model Predictions. In *Advances in Neural Information Processing Systems*, Vol. 30. 4765–4774. https://proceedings.neurips.cc/paper/2017/hash/8a20a8621978632b76c45fabd107168d-Abstract.html

[10] B. McMahan, E. Moore, D. Ramage, S. Hampson, and B. Ag"uera y Arcas. 2017. Communication-Efficient Learning of Deep Networks from Decentralized Data. In *Proceedings of the 20th International Conference on Artificial Intelligence and Statistics*, Vol. 54. 1273–1282. https://proceedings.mlr.press/v54/mcmahan17a.html

[11] L. N. Sanchez-Pinto, T. D. Bennett, P. E. DeWitt, S. Russell, M. N. Rebull, B. Martin, et al. 2024. Development and Validation of the Phoenix Criteria for Pediatric Sepsis and Septic Shock. *JAMA* 331, 8 (2024), 675–686. doi:10.1001/jama.2024.0196

[12] L. J. Schlapbach, R. S. Watson, L. R. Sorce, A. C. Argent, K. Menon, M. W. Hall, et al. 2024. International Consensus Criteria for Pediatric Sepsis and Septic Shock. *JAMA* 331, 8 (2024), 665–674. doi:10.1001/jama.2024.0179

[13] Z. Yang, X. Cui, and Z. Song. 2023. Predicting Sepsis Onset in ICU Using Machine Learning Models: A Systematic Review and Meta-Analysis. *BMC Infectious Diseases* 23, 1 (2023), 635. doi:10.1186/s12879-023-08614-0

[14] X. Zeng, G. Yu, Y. Lu, L. Tan, X. Wu, S. Shi, H. Duan, Q. Shu, and H. Li. 2020. PIC, a Paediatric-Specific Intensive Care Database. *Scientific Data* 7 (2020), 184. doi:10.1038/s41597-020-0355-4